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DATA ENGINEERING COURSE

Pandas: Data Selection & Filtering

CLASS NOTES

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Pandas – Data Selection & Filtering

1. Session Overview

This session focused on the core data selection and filtering capabilities of the Pandas library, which form the foundation of nearly every data manipulation task performed in a modern data pipeline. Students learned how to select specific columns from a **DataFrame**, retrieve rows using both label-based and position-based indexing, filter records using Boolean conditions, and reorder data using single and multi-column sorting.

These operations are used constantly in data engineering work – from inspecting raw data during exploration, to building transformation logic in ETL/ELT pipelines, to preparing clean, sorted, filtered datasets for downstream consumers such as dashboards, machine learning models, and reporting systems.

2. Learning Objectives

By the end of this session, students will be able to:

- Select a single column or multiple columns from a Pandas **DataFrame**.
 - Understand the difference between a Pandas **Series** and a Pandas **DataFrame** when selecting columns.
 - Select rows using label-based indexing with `loc[]`.
 - Select rows using position-based indexing with `iloc[]`.
 - Select specific rows and columns together using `loc[]` and `iloc[]`.
 - Apply Boolean indexing to filter a **DataFrame** based on one or more conditions.
 - Use comparison operators (`>`, `<`, `>=`, `<=`, `==`, `!=`) and logical operators (`&`, `|`, `~`) correctly inside filtering expressions.
 - Sort a **DataFrame** by a single column or by multiple columns, in ascending or descending order.
 - Recognize common mistakes made while selecting, filtering, and sorting data, and how to avoid them.
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3. Column Selection

3.1 Definition

Column selection refers to extracting one or more columns from a **DataFrame**. Pandas provides simple, intuitive syntax for retrieving columns either as a one-dimensional **Series** (single column) or as a two-dimensional **DataFrame** (multiple columns).

3.2 Detailed Explanation

A Pandas **DataFrame** is essentially a collection of columns (**Series**) sharing a common index. Selecting a single column with square-bracket notation, such as `df["Age"]`, returns a **Series** object. Selecting multiple columns requires passing a **list of column names** inside the square brackets, such as `df[["Name", "Age"]]`, which always returns a **DataFrame** – even if the list contains only one column name.

3.3 Why It Is Important

Column selection is usually the very first operation performed on a dataset. Before any filtering, transformation, or aggregation can happen, a data engineer typically needs to narrow a wide dataset down to only the relevant fields, which reduces memory usage and improves processing speed in downstream operations.

3.4 Code Example

```
import pandas as pd

employees = pd.DataFrame({
    "Name": ["Vibhore", "Manav", "Aditi", "Sachi", "Ayush", "Manendar"],
    "Department": ["IT", "IT", "Finance", "HR", "HR", "IT"],
    "Age": [24, 25, 26, 27, 28, 20]
}, index=[101, 102, 103, 104, 105, 106])

# Select a single column -> returns a Series
print(employees["Age"])

# Select multiple columns -> returns a DataFrame
print(employees[["Name", "Age"]])

# Confirm the return type of a multi-column selection
print(type(employees[["Name", "Age"]]))
```

3.5 Expected Output

```
101 24
102 25
103 26
104 27
105 28
106 20
Name: Age, dtype: int64

Name Age
101 Vibhore 24
102 Manav 25
103 Aditi 26
104 Sachi 27
105 Ayush 28
106 Manendar 20

<class 'pandas.core.frame.DataFrame'>
```

3.6 Line-by-Line Explanation

- `employees["Age"]` – accesses the **Age** column using its column label inside single square brackets; the result is a Series indexed by the DataFrame's row index.
- `employees[["Name", "Age"]]` – the inner square brackets create a Python list of column names; this list is then used to index the DataFrame, returning a new DataFrame containing only those columns, in the order specified.
- `type(...)` – confirms that double-bracket selection always produces a `pandas.core.frame.DataFrame`, never a Series.

3.7 Execution Flow

Pandas first looks up the requested label(s) in the DataFrame's column index. For a single label it constructs a Series view backed by the underlying NumPy array of that column. For a list of labels it builds a new DataFrame whose columns are reordered to match the list supplied, copying references to the relevant column data.

3.8 Best Practices

- Use a list of columns – even for a single column – when you want the result to remain a DataFrame (useful for chaining further DataFrame-only methods).
- Select only the columns you actually need as early as possible in a pipeline to reduce memory footprint, especially with wide datasets.
- Prefer column selection over `.drop()` when you only need a small subset of columns from a wide table.

3.9 Common Mistakes

- Using a single set of brackets with multiple column names, e.g. `df["Name", "Age"]`, which raises a `KeyError` because Pandas interprets it as one tuple-shaped label rather than two separate column names.
- Referencing a column name that does not exist or has different casing/spacing, which raises a `KeyError`.
- Assuming single-column selection returns a DataFrame, then calling DataFrame-only methods on it and getting an `AttributeError`.

NOTE: Single brackets with one label → Series. Double brackets (a list) → always a DataFrame.

3.10 Key Takeaways

- `df["col"]` returns a Series.
- `df[["col1", "col2"]]` returns a DataFrame.
- Column order in the output follows the order of the list you provide.

4. Row Selection – loc and iloc

4.1 Definition

Pandas offers two complementary accessors for selecting rows (and optionally columns): `loc[]`, which selects data by **label**, and `iloc[]`, which selects data by integer **position**.

4.2 Detailed Explanation – loc[]

`loc[]` is label-based. It looks up rows (and columns) using the actual index labels or column names assigned to the DataFrame, not their numeric position. When slicing with `loc[]`, for example `df.loc[101:106]`, the slice is **inclusive of the end label**, which is different from standard Python slicing behavior.

4.3 Detailed Explanation – iloc[]

`iloc[]` is purely position-based, behaving like standard Python list indexing. It always uses integers 0, 1, 2, ... regardless of what the actual index labels are. Slices with `iloc[]` follow normal Python slicing rules, meaning the end position is **excluded**.

4.4 Why It Is Important

Almost every real-world data task requires retrieving a subset of rows – a specific record by its ID, the first N rows of a sample, or a defined range of records for batch processing. Knowing precisely when to use label-based versus position-based selection prevents subtle, hard-to-debug data errors.

4.5 Code Examples

```
# loc[] -> Label-based selection

# Fetch a single row by its label
print(employees.loc[101])

# Fetch multiple rows by a list of labels
print(employees.loc[[101, 106]])

# Fetch a range of rows by label (end label IS included)
print(employees.loc[101:106])

# Select specific rows AND specific columns together
print(employees.loc[102:104, ["Name", "Age"]])
```

Note: loc[101:106] includes the row labelled 106, unlike standard Python slicing.

```
# iloc[] -> Position-based selection

# Fetch a single row by its position
print(employees.iloc[4])

# Fetch multiple rows by a list of positions
print(employees.iloc[[0, 5]])

# Fetch a range of rows by position (end position is EXCLUDED)
print(employees.iloc[0:2])
```

4.6 Expected Output (Selected Examples)

```
# employees.loc[101]
Name Vibhore
Department IT
Age 24
Name: 101, dtype: object

# employees.loc[102:104, ["Name", "Age"]]
Name Age
102 Manav 25
103 Aditi 26
104 Sachi 27

# employees.iloc[0:2]
Name Department Age
101 Vibhore IT 24
102 Manav IT 25
```

4.7 Line-by-Line Explanation

- `employees.loc[101]` – returns the single row whose index label equals 101, as a Series (since only one axis was reduced).
- `employees.loc[[101, 106]]` – passing a list of labels returns a DataFrame containing exactly those rows, in the order given.
- `employees.loc[101:106]` – a label slice; because `loc` is inclusive of the end label, the row labelled 106 is included in the result.
- `employees.loc[102:104, ["Name", "Age"]]` – the first argument selects rows by label range, the second argument (after the comma) selects specific columns; both are applied together.
- `employees.iloc[4]` – returns the row at position 4 (the 5th row), counting from zero, regardless of its index label.
- `employees.iloc[0:2]` – a position slice that returns rows at positions 0 and 1 only; position 2 is excluded, exactly like a Python list slice.

4.8 Execution Flow

With `loc[]`, Pandas first resolves the supplied labels against the DataFrame's index, then builds the result by collecting matching rows in the order the labels were requested. With `iloc[]`, Pandas bypasses the index labels entirely and works directly against the row's ordinal position in memory, similar to indexing a NumPy array.

4.9 Best Practices

- Use `loc[]` when you know meaningful identifiers (IDs, dates, names) and want to select by them.
- Use `iloc[]` when you need positional access – for example, the first N rows, or the last row, irrespective of index labels.
- When combining row and column selection, always pass both inside a single set of brackets separated by a comma: `df.loc[rows, cols]`.

4.10 Common Mistakes

- Forgetting that `loc[]` slices are **inclusive** of the end label, while `iloc[]` slices are **exclusive** of the end position – a very common source of off-by-one errors.
- Using `iloc[]` with non-integer labels, which raises a `TypeError`.
- Using `loc[]` with a label that does not exist in the index, which raises a `KeyError`.
- Mixing up the order of arguments – remember it is always `[rows, columns]`, never the reverse.

REMEMBER: `loc` -> label-based, end label INCLUDED. `iloc` -> position-based, end position EXCLUDED.

4.11 Key Takeaways

- `loc[]` works with labels; `iloc[]` works with integer positions.
- Both accept row-only selection or combined row-and-column selection using a comma.
- Slicing behavior differs between the two – this is the single most-tested concept in interviews on this topic.

5. Boolean Indexing (Filtering)

5.1 Definition

Boolean indexing (also called Boolean filtering or masking) is the process of selecting rows from a `DataFrame` based on whether they satisfy one or more conditions that evaluate to `True` or `False` for each row.

5.2 Detailed Explanation

Writing a condition such as `employees["Department"] == "IT"` produces a `Boolean Series` – one `True/False` value per row. Passing this `Boolean Series` back into the `DataFrame`'s square brackets, `employees[condition]`, returns only the rows where the condition is `True`. Multiple conditions can be combined using logical operators, but each individual condition **must** be wrapped in parentheses.

5.3 Why It Is Important

Filtering data based on business rules – active customers, transactions above a threshold, records within a date range – is one of the most frequent operations in any data pipeline. Boolean indexing is the standard, vectorized way to do this efficiently in `Pandas`, without writing slow Python-level loops.

5.4 Code Examples

```
# Comparison operators: >, <, >=, <=, ==, !=
# Logical operators: & (and), | (or), ~ (not)

# Single condition
print(employees[employees["Department"] == "IT"])

# Negation using ~
print(employees[~(employees["Department"] == "IT")])

# Multiple conditions -> parentheses around each condition are mandatory
print(employees[
    (employees["Department"] == "IT") & (employees["Age"] > 24)
])

print(employees[
    (employees["Department"] == "HR") | (employees["Department"] == "Finance")
])
```

5.5 Expected Output

```
# employees[employees["Department"] == "IT"]
Name Department Age
101 Vibhore IT 24
102 Manav IT 25
106 Manendar IT 20

# employees[(employees["Department"] == "IT") & (employees["Age"] > 24)]
Name Department Age
102 Manav IT 25
```

5.6 Line-by-Line Explanation

- `employees["Department"] == "IT"` – produces a Boolean Series with one True/False value for every row, comparing each row's Department value to the string "IT".
- `employees[condition]` – the outer square brackets accept this Boolean Series as a **mask** and keep only the rows where the mask is True.
- `~( . . . )` – the tilde operator inverts a Boolean Series, flipping True to False and vice versa, used here to select everyone **not** in IT.
- `(cond1) & (cond2)` – the ampersand performs an element-wise logical AND between two Boolean Series; both conditions must individually be wrapped in parentheses because of Python's operator precedence rules.

5.7 Execution Flow

Pandas evaluates each comparison expression independently across the entire column (a vectorized, NumPy-backed operation), producing a Boolean Series the same length as the DataFrame. When multiple Boolean Series are combined with `&` or `|`, Pandas performs an element-wise logical operation between them, position by position, to produce the final mask used to filter rows.

5.8 Best Practices

- Always wrap each individual condition in parentheses when combining multiple conditions.
- Use `&`, `|`, and `~` instead of Python's `and`, `or`, `not`, which do not work element-wise on Series.
- For checking membership in a list of values, prefer `df["col"].isin([...])` over chaining several `==` conditions with `|`.

5.9 Common Mistakes

- Omitting parentheses around individual conditions, which raises a `TypeError` due to Python operator precedence.
- Using `and/or` instead of `&/|`, which raises a `ValueError: The truth value of a Series is ambiguous`.
- Forgetting the tilde `~` when negating a condition and instead trying to use `!=` across an entire compound expression.

REMEMBER: Parentheses around every condition are mandatory when combining filters with `&` or `|`.

5.10 Key Takeaways

- A condition on a column produces a Boolean Series the same length as the DataFrame.
- Passing that Boolean Series back into `df[...]` filters the rows.
- Combine conditions only with `&`, `|`, `~`, each wrapped in parentheses.

6. Sorting Data

6.1 Definition

Sorting reorders the rows of a DataFrame based on the values in one or more columns, using the `sort_values()` method.

6.2 Detailed Explanation

`df.sort_values("column")` sorts the DataFrame by a single column in ascending order by default. Passing `ascending=False` reverses the order. To sort by multiple columns, pass a list of column names; Pandas sorts by the first column first, then uses subsequent columns to break ties. Each column in the list can have its own ascending/descending direction by passing a matching list to the `ascending` parameter.

6.3 Why It Is Important

Sorted output is essential for reporting, ranking (e.g. top N records), generating leaderboards, preparing time-series data in chronological order, and producing consistent, deterministic output for downstream consumers and tests.

6.4 Code Examples

```
# Sort by a single column, descending
print(employees.sort_values("Age", ascending=False))

# Sort by multiple columns with independent directions
print(employees.sort_values(
    ["Department", "Age"],
    ascending=[True, False]
))
```

6.5 Expected Output

```
# employees.sort_values("Age", ascending=False)
Name Department Age
105 Ayush HR 28
104 Sachi HR 27
103 Aditi Finance 26
102 Manav IT 25
101 Vibhore IT 24
106 Manendar IT 20
```

6.6 Line-by-Line Explanation

- `sort_values("Age")` – sorts every row according to the values in the Age column.
- `ascending=False` – reverses the default ascending order so the highest age appears first.
- `sort_values(["Department", "Age"], ascending=[True, False])` – first groups rows by Department in ascending (A–Z) order; within each Department group, rows are then ordered by Age in descending order.

6.7 Execution Flow

Internally, `sort_values()` performs a stable sort: it orders rows by the first key column, and for any rows that tie on that key, falls back to the next key column in the list, and so on, while preserving original row order for any remaining ties.

6.8 Best Practices

- Use `reset_index(drop=True)` after sorting if you want a clean, sequential index in the output.
- Sort only by the columns required for the final output – sorting is a relatively expensive operation on large datasets.
- When sorting by multiple columns, make sure the ascending list has the same length and order as the column list.

6.9 Common Mistakes

- Forgetting that `sort_values()` returns a **new** DataFrame by default and does not modify the original in place (unless `inplace=True` is passed).
- Providing a single ascending value while sorting by multiple columns, which applies that single direction to every column rather than one per column.
- Sorting by a column containing mixed types (e.g. strings and numbers), which raises a `TypeError`.

REMEMBER: `sort_values()` is non-destructive by default – always assign the result to a variable or chain further operations on it.

6.10 Key Takeaways

- `df.sort_values("col")` sorts ascending by default.
- `ascending=False` reverses the order.
- A list of columns enables multi-level sorting, with an independent direction per column.

7. Real-World Data Engineering Perspective

7.1 Why Data Engineers Use These Operations

Selection, indexing, filtering, and sorting are the building blocks of nearly every transformation step in a data pipeline. They appear constantly in raw-to-clean data transformations, business-rule application, and the preparation of data for analytics, machine learning, and reporting layers.

7.2 Where They Appear in Data Pipelines

- **Extraction validation:** after pulling raw data, engineers select and inspect key columns to validate schema and content before further processing.
- **Transformation (the T in ETL/ELT):** Boolean indexing is used to apply business rules such as removing invalid records, isolating specific customer segments, or splitting data into valid/invalid partitions.
- **Loading and reporting:** sorted, filtered subsets are produced as the final output loaded into a data warehouse table, a BI dashboard, or an API response.
- **Orchestrated pipelines:** in tools like Apache Airflow, a Python task using these exact Pandas operations frequently sits between an extraction task and a loading task.

7.3 ETL / ELT Relevance

In an ETL workflow, row and column selection narrow the dataset to required fields early (reducing the volume that flows through the rest of the pipeline), Boolean indexing enforces business and data-quality rules during the transform stage, and sorting prepares data in the exact order required before loading into the destination system – for example, chronological order for time-series tables in a warehouse such as BigQuery or Snowflake.

7.4 Production Use Cases

- Filtering out test accounts or null/invalid records before loading into a production warehouse table.
- Selecting only PII-free columns when producing a dataset for downstream teams without appropriate access.
- Sorting transaction records by timestamp before computing running totals or window-style aggregations in a PySpark or SQLAlchemy-driven pipeline.
- Building dbt-style staging models where the equivalent SQL `WHERE` and `ORDER BY` clauses mirror exactly the Boolean indexing and `sort_values()` logic learned in this session.

7.5 Scalability Considerations

Pandas operations like these are vectorized and reasonably efficient for datasets that fit comfortably in memory, but they do not scale to very large datasets. For data beyond a single machine's memory, engineers translate the same logical operations into PySpark DataFrame transformations (`select()`, `filter()`, `orderBy()`) or push the filtering and sorting down into SQL executed by the source database or warehouse, which is generally far more scalable than filtering after loading all rows into Pandas.

7.6 Performance Considerations

- Filtering and selecting columns as early as possible reduces the amount of data carried through later, more expensive steps such as joins and aggregations.
- Boolean indexing is vectorized and significantly faster than iterating over rows with a Python for loop or `.apply()`.
- Sorting is an $O(n \log n)$ operation; sorting unnecessarily large datasets, or sorting multiple times within a pipeline, adds avoidable overhead.

7.7 Common Industry Scenarios

- A data engineer receives a raw CSV extract and must select only the columns approved for a downstream marketing dataset.
- A nightly batch job filters out cancelled or refunded orders before computing daily revenue totals.
- A reporting pipeline sorts customer support tickets by priority and then by creation timestamp before they are loaded into a dashboard table.

8. Summary Section

Concept	Key Point
Column Selection	<code>df["col"]</code> -> Series. <code>df[["col1","col2"]]</code> -> DataFrame.
<code>loc[]</code>	Label-based. Slices are inclusive of the end label.
<code>iloc[]</code>	Position-based. Slices exclude the end position (Python-style).
Row + Column (<code>loc/iloc</code>)	<code>df.loc[rows, cols]</code> / <code>df.iloc[rows, cols]</code>
Boolean Indexing	<code>df[condition]</code> filters rows; wrap each condition in parentheses.
Logical Operators	Use <code>&</code> (and), <code> </code> (or), <code>~</code> (not) – never and/or/not on Series.
<code>sort_values()</code>	Ascending by default; pass a list of columns for multi-level sorting.

Frequently misunderstood concepts: the inclusive/exclusive end-point difference between `loc[]` and `iloc[]`, the requirement to parenthesize each condition in Boolean indexing, and the fact that `sort_values()` does not modify the DataFrame in place by default.

9. Quick Revision Sheet

```
# COLUMN SELECTION
df["col"] # Series
df[["col1", "col2"]] # DataFrame

# ROW SELECTION
df.loc[label] # single row by label
df.loc[[l1, l2]] # multiple rows by label
df.loc[l1:l2] # range INCLUSIVE of l2
df.loc[l1:l2, ["c1", "c2"]] # rows + columns by label

df.iloc[pos] # single row by position
df.iloc[[p1, p2]] # multiple rows by position
df.iloc[p1:p2] # range EXCLUSIVE of p2

# BOOLEAN INDEXING
df[(df["c"] > x) & (df["c2"] == y)] # AND
df[(df["c"] > x) | (df["c2"] == y)] # OR
df[~(df["c"] == y)] # NOT

# SORTING
df.sort_values("col") # ascending
df.sort_values("col", ascending=False) # descending
df.sort_values(["c1", "c2"], ascending=[True, False])
```

QUICK TIP: Reminder: loc is inclusive, iloc is exclusive. Always parenthesize Boolean conditions. sort_values() returns a new DataFrame by default.

10. General Interview Questions – Beginner Level

Q1. What is the difference between selecting a column with df["col"] and df[["col"]]?

df["col"] returns a one-dimensional Series. df[["col"]], using a list, always returns a two-dimensional DataFrame, even though it contains only a single column.

Q2. What is the difference between loc[] and iloc[]?

loc[] selects data using the actual index labels of the DataFrame, while iloc[] selects data using purely integer positions, starting from 0, regardless of the labels.

Q3. Is the end point included when slicing with loc[]?

Yes. When slicing with loc[], for example df.loc[1:5], the row labelled 5 is included in the result, unlike standard Python slicing.

Q4. Is the end point included when slicing with iloc[]?

No. iloc[] follows standard Python slicing rules, so df.iloc[1:5] returns positions 1 through 4 only; position 5 is excluded.

Q5. What does Boolean indexing mean in Pandas?

Boolean indexing means filtering a DataFrame's rows using a Boolean Series – typically produced by a comparison such as df["col"] > 10 – where only rows that evaluate to True are kept.

Q6. Why must each condition be wrapped in parentheses when combining filters?

Because Python's bitwise operators (&, |, ~), which Pandas uses for element-wise Boolean logic, have higher precedence than comparison operators. Without parentheses, Python would try to evaluate the bitwise operator before the comparison, producing an error.

Q7. Why can't we use Python's normal 'and'/'or' keywords for filtering?

Python's and/or evaluate a single overall truth value and cannot operate element-wise across an entire Series, which raises a ValueError stating that the truth value of a Series is ambiguous.

Q8. How do you sort a DataFrame in descending order by a column?

Use `df.sort_values("column_name", ascending=False)`.

Q9. How do you sort a DataFrame by multiple columns?

Pass a list of column names to `sort_values()`, optionally with a matching list passed to the `ascending` parameter to control the direction independently for each column.

Q10. Does `sort_values()` modify the original DataFrame?

No, by default it returns a new, sorted DataFrame. Passing `inplace=True` modifies the original DataFrame directly instead of returning a new one.

11. General Interview Questions – Intermediate Level

Q1. How do you select rows AND specific columns together using `loc[]`?

Pass both arguments inside the same brackets separated by a comma: `df.loc[row_selector, column_selector]`, for example `df.loc[101:104, ["Name", "Age"]]`.

Q2. What happens if you use `iloc[]` with a non-integer label?

It raises a `TypeError`, because `iloc[]` strictly expects integer positions and does not understand label-based values.

Q3. How would you filter rows where a column's value is in a specific list of values?

Use the `isin()` method, e.g. `df[df["Department"].isin(["HR", "Finance"])]`, which is cleaner and more efficient than chaining multiple equality conditions with the `|` operator.

Q4. How do you negate a complex Boolean condition cleanly?

Wrap the entire combined condition in parentheses and prefix it with the tilde operator, for example `df[~((df["Age"] > 25) & (df["Dept"] == "IT"))]`.

Q5. What is the difference between `df.loc[1:5]` and `df.iloc[1:5]` if the DataFrame has a default integer index?

If the index is the default `RangeIndex` (0,1,2,...), the labels and positions coincide numerically, but the slicing behavior still differs: `loc[1:5]` includes label 5, while `iloc[1:5]` excludes position 5, producing different-sized results.

Q6. Why might `sort_values()` with multiple ascending values raise an error?

If the length of the ascending list does not match the length of the columns list passed to `sort_values()`, Pandas raises a `ValueError` because it cannot map directions to columns.

Q7. How can you reset the index after sorting or filtering?

Chain `.reset_index(drop=True)` onto the result, which replaces the old index with a fresh sequential `RangeIndex` and discards the old index instead of adding it as a column.

Q8. What is the performance advantage of Boolean indexing over a manual loop?

Boolean indexing is vectorized – implemented in optimized C/NumPy code under the hood – so it evaluates conditions across an entire column at once, which is significantly faster than iterating row by row in pure Python.

Q9. How do you combine row selection by position with column selection by label?

Pandas does not allow mixing label and position directly in `loc[]` or `iloc[]` alone; the common approach is to use `iloc[]` with integer column positions, or first select the desired columns by label and then apply `iloc[]` for rows.

Q10. What's a key risk of using chained indexing such as `df[df["Age"]>25]["Name"] = "X"`?

Chained indexing can trigger Pandas' `SettingWithCopyWarning` because it is unclear whether the operation modifies a view or a copy of the data; the safer approach is a single `loc`-based assignment, such as `df.loc[df["Age"] > 25, "Name"] = "X"`.

12. Data Engineer Interview Preparation

This section focuses specifically on how column selection, row indexing, Boolean filtering, and sorting are applied, discussed, and tested in real Data Engineer interviews, with an emphasis on production systems, pipelines, and scalability.

Q1. In a production ETL pipeline, where would you typically apply Boolean filtering – at extraction, transformation, or loading?

Ideally as early as possible, often pushed down to the source query (SQL `WHERE` clause) during extraction, or immediately during the transform step. Filtering early reduces the data volume flowing through every subsequent stage of the pipeline.

Q2. How would you replicate Pandas-style Boolean indexing using SQL?

A Pandas filter such as `df[(df["dept"]=="IT") & (df["age"]>25)]` is logically equivalent to a SQL `WHERE` clause: `WHERE dept = 'IT' AND age > 25`. Both express the same row-level filtering logic, but SQL filtering happens inside the database engine, which is typically far more scalable.

Q3. Why might a senior engineer prefer pushing filters into the database rather than loading all rows into Pandas first?

Pushing filters into the database lets the source system use indexes and avoid transferring unnecessary rows over the network into application memory, which is far more scalable than loading the full table into a Pandas `DataFrame` and filtering afterward.

Q4. How does row selection relate to incremental/batch data pipelines?

Incremental pipelines often select only rows newer than the last successful run, typically using a Boolean filter on a timestamp or watermark column, which mirrors the Boolean indexing pattern taught in class.

Q5. What is the PySpark equivalent of Pandas' `loc/iloc`-based row selection?

PySpark `DataFrames` don't expose `loc/iloc` directly; instead engineers use `.filter()` or `.where()` with column expressions, and `.limit()/.take()` for positional-style row retrieval, since Spark `DataFrames` are distributed and

lack a single ordered positional index like Pandas.

Q6. How would you handle filtering a dataset that is too large to fit into memory?

Use a distributed engine such as PySpark, or filter at the SQL/source level (in a warehouse like BigQuery or Snowflake) rather than loading the entire dataset into Pandas, or process the data in smaller chunks using chunked reads.

Q7. Why is sorting before loading data into a data warehouse table sometimes important?

Some destination systems and storage formats (such as partitioned/clustered tables) benefit from data being pre-sorted on key columns, which can improve compression and query performance for range-based queries.

Q8. What's the risk of sorting very large datasets inside a single-node Pandas process?

Sorting is an $O(n \log n)$ operation and Pandas runs on a single machine's memory and CPU; extremely large datasets can exhaust memory or take excessive time, so very large sorts are usually delegated to distributed engines or the database itself.

Q9. How would you explain the difference between loc/iloc to someone using SQLAlchemy for the first time?

loc/iloc deal with retrieving rows from an in-memory DataFrame by label or position, whereas SQLAlchemy is used to query rows from a relational database using SQL expressions (equivalent to WHERE/ORDER BY); the concepts are similar logically but operate on different layers of a data stack.

Q10. Give a real production scenario combining column selection, filtering, and sorting in one transformation step.

A nightly job extracts raw order data, selects only the columns required downstream (order_id, customer_id, amount, status), filters out cancelled or refunded orders with Boolean indexing, and sorts the remaining records by order timestamp before loading the result into a reporting table.

Q11. How do you avoid the SettingWithCopyWarning when filtering and then modifying a DataFrame?

Avoid chained indexing (two separate bracket operations in sequence); instead perform the filter and assignment in a single loc-based statement, such as `df.loc[df["status"]=="active", "flag"] = 1`, or explicitly call `.copy()` if you intend to work on an independent subset.

Q12. How does multi-column sorting relate to composite keys in a data warehouse?

Multi-column sorting mirrors how composite/clustering keys order data in a warehouse table – sorting by department then age in Pandas is conceptually the same as clustering a table by (department, age) for faster range scans on those columns.

Q13. What follow-up question might an interviewer ask after you explain Boolean indexing?

A common follow-up is: 'How would this scale to 100 million rows?' – testing whether the candidate understands that Pandas Boolean indexing works well in memory but should be translated to SQL or a distributed engine like Spark for large-scale data.

Q14. Why might an interviewer ask you to filter data inside a Kafka-consuming pipeline?

To test whether you understand that filtering can happen at the streaming layer itself (per-message Boolean checks before any data is even written to a sink), which is more efficient than first writing every message to a table and filtering afterward.

Q15. How would you justify selecting only required columns in a pipeline feeding a machine learning model managed via Airflow?

Selecting only the required feature columns early reduces I/O and memory usage across every downstream Airflow task, speeds up serialization between tasks (e.g. via Parquet files), and avoids accidentally exposing unnecessary or sensitive columns to the model training step.